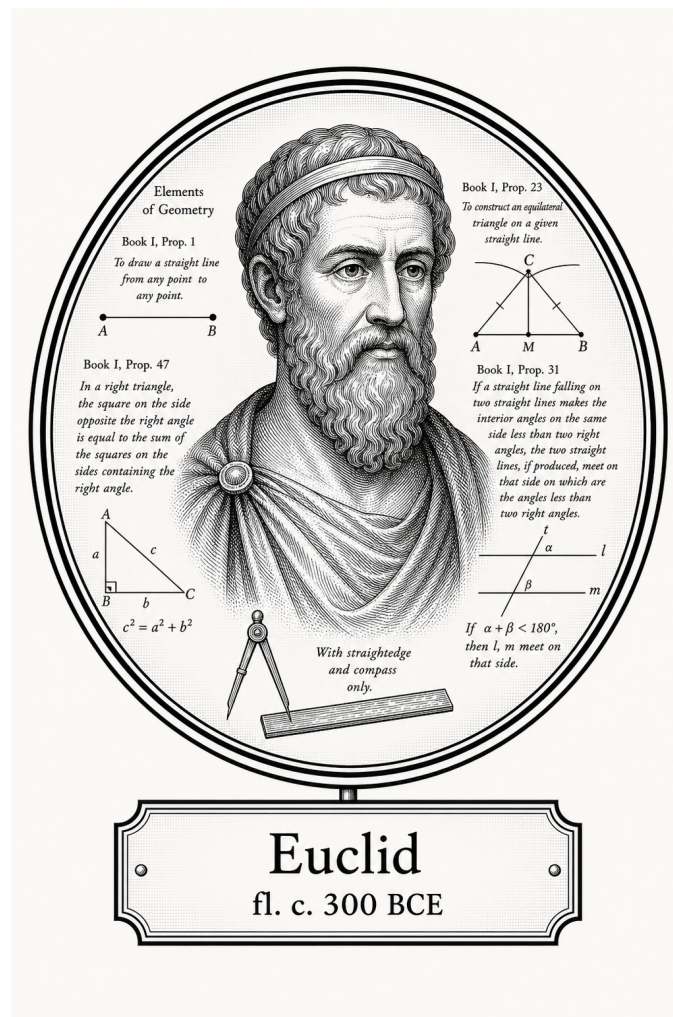


FROM CANTOR TO ITO

Logic, Sets, and Proof

Foundational Geometry



Euclid

fl. c. 300 BCE

Self-Study Notes

William Sollers

July 1, 2026

For every reader learning to make mathematics their own.

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Chapter 1

Euclidean Geometry



1.1 Foundations

Definitions

Remark (Source note). The following definitions are Euclid’s Book I definitions in the Heath translation [Euclid, 1956, Book I, Definitions 1–23].

Definition

Definition 1.1.1 (Point). A point is that which has no part.

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Definition

Definition 1.1.2 (Line). A line is breadthless length.

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Definition

Definition 1.1.3 (Ends of a line). The ends of a line are points.

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Definition

Definition 1.1.4 (Straight line). A straight line is a line which lies evenly with the points on itself.

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Definition

Definition 1.1.5 (Surface). A surface is that which has length and breadth only.

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Definition

Definition 1.1.6 (Edges of a surface). The edges of a surface are lines.

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Definition

Definition 1.1.7 (Plane surface). A plane surface is a surface which lies evenly with the straight lines on itself.

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Definition

Definition 1.1.8 (Plane angle). A plane angle is the inclination to one another of two lines in a plane which meet one another and do not lie in a straight line.

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Definition

Definition 1.1.9 (Rectilinear angle). And when the lines containing the angle are straight, the angle is called rectilinear.

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a

modern first-order formalization.

Definition

Definition 1.1.10 (Right angle and perpendicular). When a straight line standing on a straight line makes the adjacent angles equal to one another, each of the equal angles is right, and the straight line standing on the other is called a perpendicular to that on which it stands.

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Definition

Definition 1.1.11 (Obtuse angle). An obtuse angle is an angle greater than a right angle.

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Definition

Definition 1.1.12 (Acute angle). An acute angle is an angle less than a right angle.

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Definition

Definition 1.1.13 (Boundary). A boundary is that which is an extremity of anything.

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Definition

Definition 1.1.14 (Figure). A figure is that which is contained by any boundary or boundaries.

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Definition

Definition 1.1.15 (Circle). A circle is a plane figure contained by one line such that all the straight lines falling upon it from one point among those lying within the figure equal one another.

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Definition

Definition 1.1.16 (Center of a circle). And the point is called the center of the circle.

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Definition

Definition 1.1.17 (Diameter). A diameter of the circle is any straight line drawn through the center and terminated in both directions by the circumference of the circle, and such a straight line also bisects the circle.

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Definition

Definition 1.1.18 (Semicircle). A semicircle is the figure contained by the diameter and the circumference cut off by it. And the center of the semicircle is the same as that of the circle.

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Definition

Definition 1.1.19 (Rectilinear figures). Rectilinear figures are those which are contained by straight lines, trilateral figures being those contained by three, quadrilateral those contained by four, and multilateral those contained by more than four straight lines.

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Definition

Definition 1.1.20 (Equilateral, isosceles, and scalene triangles). Of trilateral figures, an equilateral triangle is that which has its three sides equal, an isosceles triangle that which has two of its sides alone equal, and a scalene triangle that which has its three sides unequal.

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Definition

Definition 1.1.21 (Right-angled, obtuse-angled, and acute-angled triangles). Further, of trilateral figures, a right-angled triangle is that which has a right angle, an obtuse-angled triangle that which has an obtuse angle, and an acute-angled triangle that which has its three angles acute.

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Definition

Definition 1.1.22 (Quadrilateral classes). Of quadrilateral figures, a square is that which is both equilateral and right-angled; an oblong that which is right-angled but not equilateral; a rhombus that which is equilateral but not right-angled; and a rhomboid that which has its opposite sides and angles equal to one another but is neither equilateral nor right-angled. And let quadrilaterals other than these be called trapezia.

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Definition

Definition 1.1.23 (Parallel straight lines). Parallel straight lines are straight lines which, being in the same plane and being produced indefinitely in both directions, do not meet one another in either direction.

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Postulates

Remark (Source note). The following are Euclid's five postulates from Book I of the *Elements* in the Heath translation [Euclid, 1956, Book I, Postulates 1–5].

Remark (Exposition). Postulates are geometry-specific starting assumptions. They say which constructions are permitted and which basic geometric facts may be used without proof. In Euclid's system, these are not conclusions reached from earlier results; they are part of the foundation from which the theory begins.

Later propositions are proved from the definitions, the postulates, the common notions, and propositions already established. Thus the postulates are the rules of play for Euclidean geometry: they determine what can be constructed, what may be assumed about straight lines and circles, and where the theory's geometric content enters before proof begins.

Axiom

Axiom 1.1.24 (Euclid Postulate I: Drawing a straight line). Let it have been postulated to draw a straight line from any point to any point.

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Axiom

Axiom 1.1.25 (Euclid Postulate II: Producing a finite straight line). Let it have been postulated to produce a finite straight line continuously in a straight line.

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Axiom

Axiom 1.1.26 (Euclid Postulate III: Describing a circle). Let it have been postulated to describe a circle with any center and distance.

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Axiom

Axiom 1.1.27 (Euclid Postulate IV: Equality of right angles). Let it have been postulated that all right angles are equal to one another.

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Axiom

Axiom 1.1.28 (Euclid Postulate V: Parallel postulate). Let it have been postulated that, if a straight line falling on two straight lines makes the interior angles on the same side less than two right angles, the two straight lines, if produced indefinitely, meet on that side on which are the angles less than the two right angles.

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Axioms

Remark (Source note). Euclid calls the following principles *common notions*. They function as general axioms governing equality and comparison in Book I of the *Elements* [Euclid, 1956, Book I, Common Notions 1–5].

Axiom

Axiom 1.1.29 (Euclid Common Notion I: Equality is transitive through a common equal). Things which are equal to the same thing are also equal to one another.

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Axiom

Axiom 1.1.30 (Euclid Common Notion II: Adding equals to equals). If equals be added to equals, the wholes are equal.

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Axiom

Axiom 1.1.31 (Euclid Common Notion III: Subtracting equals from equals). If equals be subtracted from equals, the remainders are equal.

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Axiom

Axiom 1.1.32 (Euclid Common Notion IV: Coincidence implies equality). Things which coincide with one another are equal to one another.

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Axiom

Axiom 1.1.33 (Euclid Common Notion V: Whole and part). The whole is greater than the part.

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Remark (Exposition). Common notions are general principles of reasoning rather than specifically geometric assumptions. They express basic behavior of equality, comparison, and logical transfer: equal things may be substituted for equal things, adding or subtracting equals preserves equality, and a whole exceeds its part.

Because these principles are not tied to points, lines, circles, or planes, they can be used throughout mathematics, not only in geometry. In modern language, they play the role of background axioms governing how equality and comparison may be used inside proofs.

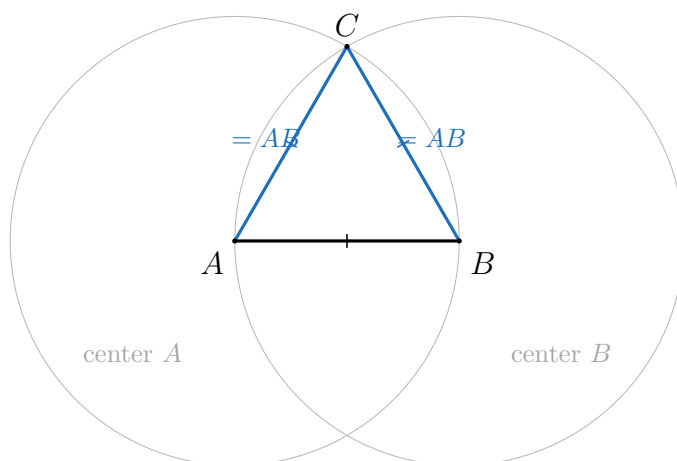
1.2 Compass-and-Straightedge Constructions

Propositions

Remark (Source note). The following propositions are selected from Euclid's Book I in modern theorem form, following the Heath translation of the *Elements* [Euclid, 1956, Book I]. The selection is curated for the trigonometric construction: congruence, parallel-angle control, triangle angle-sum, area comparison, square construction, and the Pythagorean theorem.

Theorem

Theorem 1.2.1 (Euclid I.1: Constructing an equilateral triangle). *Given a finite straight line segment AB , there exists an equilateral triangle ABC constructed on AB .*

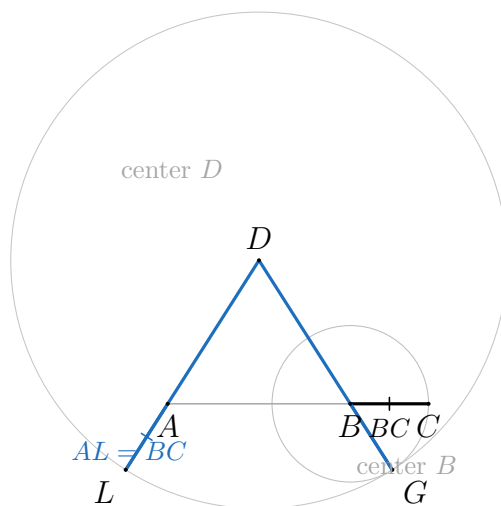


Remark (Proof). [Go to proof.](#)

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Theorem

Theorem 1.2.2 (Euclid I.2: Copying a segment from a given point). *Given a point A and a finite straight line segment BC , there exists a straight line segment beginning at A and equal to BC .*

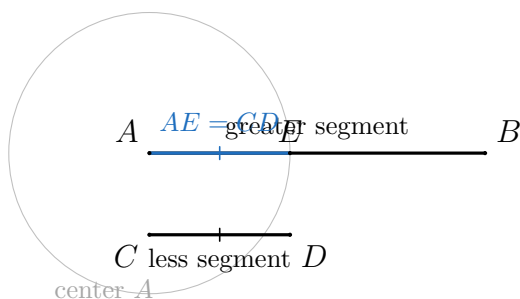


Remark (Proof). [Go to proof.](#)

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Theorem

Theorem 1.2.3 (Euclid I.3: Cutting off an equal segment). *Given two unequal finite straight line segments, there exists a construction which cuts off from the greater a straight line segment equal to the less.*

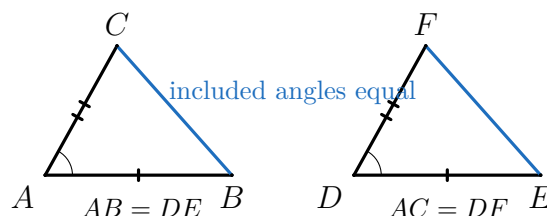


Remark (Proof). [Go to proof.](#)

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Theorem

Theorem 1.2.4 (Euclid I.4: Side-angle-side congruence). *If two triangles have two sides equal to two sides respectively, and have the angles contained by the equal straight lines equal, then they also have the base equal to the base, the triangle equal to the triangle, and the remaining angles equal to the remaining angles respectively.*

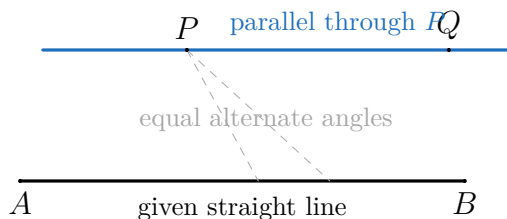


Remark (Proof). [Go to proof.](#)

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Theorem

Theorem 1.2.5 (Euclid I.31: Drawing a parallel through a point). *Through a given point, to draw a straight line parallel to a given straight line.*

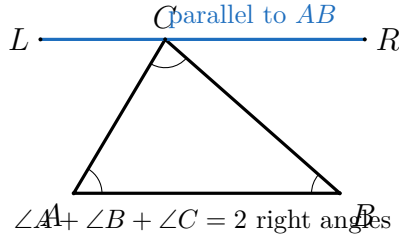


Remark (Proof). [Go to proof.](#)

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Theorem

Theorem 1.2.6 (Euclid I.32: Triangle angle sum). *In any triangle, if one of the sides is produced, then the exterior angle is equal to the two interior and opposite angles, and the three interior angles of the triangle are equal to two right angles.*

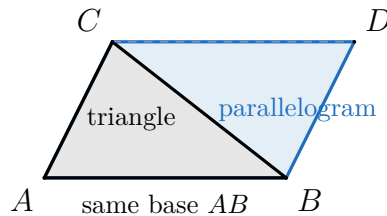


Remark (Proof). [Go to proof.](#)

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Theorem

Theorem 1.2.7 (Euclid I.41: Triangle and parallelogram on the same base). *If a parallelogram has the same base with a triangle and is in the same parallels, then the parallelogram is double the triangle.*

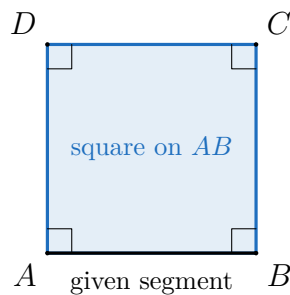


Remark (Proof). [Go to proof.](#)

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Theorem

Theorem 1.2.8 (Euclid I.46: Constructing a square on a segment). *On a given straight line, to describe a square.*

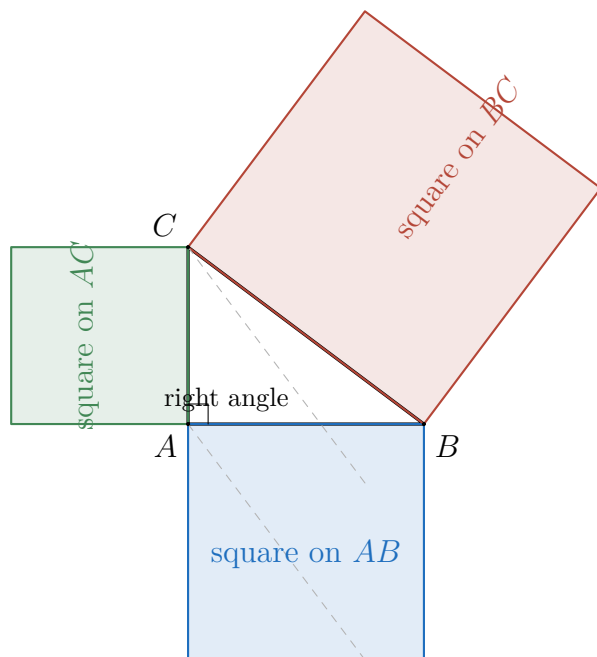


Remark (Proof). [Go to proof.](#)

Remark (Standard quantified statement). This is a classical Euclidean source-text clause. In this chapter it is treated as a named primitive statement rather than expanded into a modern first-order formalization.

Theorem

Theorem 1.2.9 (Euclid I.47: Pythagorean theorem). *In right-angled triangles, the square on the side subtending the right angle is equal to the squares on the sides containing the right angle.*



Remark (Proof). [Go to proof.](#)

Remark (Placement). This proposition is pulled forward as the Book I capstone needed by the trigonometric definitions. Its professional proof depends on later Book I propositions that are not yet developed in this chapter; the proof file records those pending Euclidean nodes explicitly.

Proofs

Remark (Return). [Return to Theorem](#)

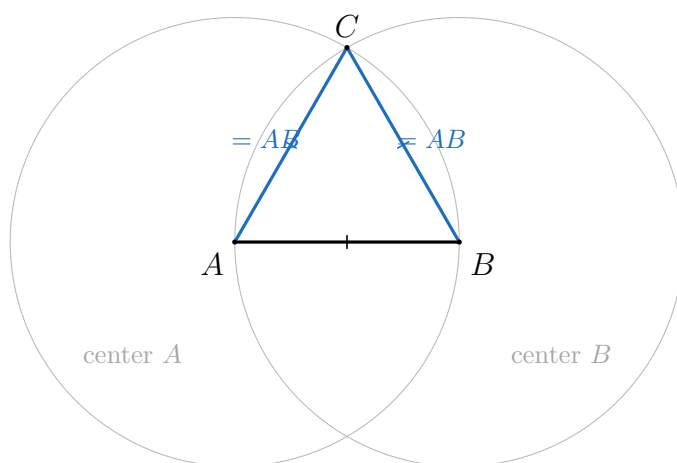
Theorem (Euclid I.1: Constructing an equilateral triangle). *Given a finite straight line segment AB , there exists an equilateral triangle ABC constructed on AB .*

Professional Standard Proof.

Let AB be the given finite straight line. Describe the circle with center A and radius AB , and describe the circle with center B and radius BA . Let C be an intersection point of the two circles, and draw the straight lines CA and CB .

Since C lies on the circle with center A , $AC = AB$. Since C lies on the circle with center B , $BC = BA$. Thus AC and BC are each equal to AB , so by Common Notion I they are equal to one another. Therefore AB , BC , and CA are equal, and the triangle ABC is equilateral. $\square$

Detailed Learning Proof.



The construction uses exactly the permitted tools available at this point. Postulate I allows the given segment AB to be treated as a drawable straight line segment. Postulate III allows a circle with any center and distance, so we may draw one circle centered at A with distance AB and another centered at B with distance BA .

Choose an intersection point C of the two circles. The segment AC is a radius of the circle centered at A , so it equals the radius AB . The segment BC is a radius of the circle centered at B , so it equals the radius BA , which is the same segment as AB . Hence all three sides of $\triangle ABC$ are equal, and by the definition of an equilateral triangle, $\triangle ABC$ is equilateral. $\square$

Remark (Proof structure). Construct two circles from the endpoints of the given segment, draw the two radii to an intersection point, and use equality through the common segment AB to identify the three sides.

Remark (Euclid's intersection gap). The proof assumes that the two circles meet. This is the classical lacuna in Euclid I.1: the postulates permit drawing the circles, but Euclid's stated axioms do not by themselves include a circle-circle intersection principle. Later axiomatizations add continuity or incidence assumptions that justify this step.

Remark (Dependencies).

- Point
- Straight line
- Circle
- Equilateral triangle
- Euclid Postulate I
- Euclid Postulate III
- Euclid Common Notion I

Remark (Return). [Return to Theorem](#)

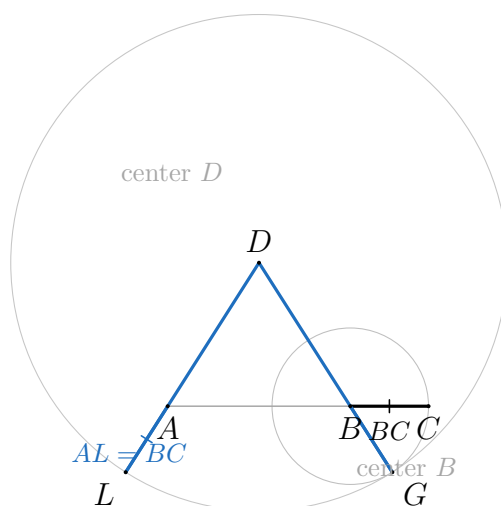
Theorem (Euclid I.2: Copying a segment from a given point). *Given a point A and a finite straight line segment BC , there exists a straight line segment beginning at A and equal to BC .*

Professional Standard Proof.

Let A be the given point and let BC be the given segment. Join AB and construct an equilateral triangle DAB on AB by Euclid I.1. Produce the straight lines DA and DB . With center B and distance BC , describe a circle meeting the produced line DB at G . With center D and distance DG , describe a circle meeting the produced line DA at L .

Since $BG = BC$ and $DL = DG$, while $DA = DB$ because DAB is equilateral, the remainders AL and BG are equal. Therefore $AL = BC$. Thus from the point A a straight line segment equal to the given segment BC has been constructed. $\square$

Detailed Learning Proof.



The role of the equilateral triangle is to create two matching initial lengths: $DA = DB$. After the side DB is extended, the circle centered at B marks a point G with $BG = BC$. Then the circle centered at D transfers the full length DG onto the other produced side, giving $DL = DG$.

Now compare the two long segments from D . On one side, $DG = DB + BG$; on the other, $DL = DA + AL$. Since $DG = DL$ and $DB = DA$, subtracting the equal initial parts leaves $BG = AL$. But $BG = BC$, so $AL = BC$ by Common Notion I. The segment AL begins at the required point A and has the required length. $\square$

Remark (Proof structure). Euclid I.2 is a transfer construction. It does not assume a compass can be lifted and moved directly; instead it copies the length BC using only straight lines, produced straight lines, circles, Euclid I.1, and common notions about equality.

Remark (Dependencies).

- [Point](#)

- Straight line
- Circle
- Euclid I.1
- Euclid Postulate I
- Euclid Postulate II
- Euclid Postulate III
- Euclid Common Notion I

Remark (Return). [Return to Theorem](#)

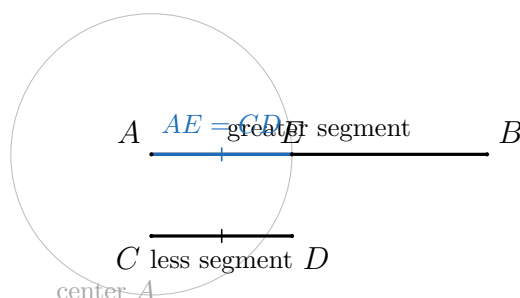
Theorem (Euclid I.3: Cutting off an equal segment). *Given two unequal finite straight line segments, there exists a construction which cuts off from the greater a straight line segment equal to the less.*

Professional Standard Proof.

Let AB be the greater of the two given unequal segments and let CD be the less. By Euclid I.2, construct from the point A a segment AD equal to CD . With center A and distance AD , describe a circle meeting AB at E .

Since AE and AD are radii of the same circle, $AE = AD$. Since $AD = CD$ by construction, $AE = CD$ by Common Notion I. Therefore the segment AE has been cut off from the greater segment AB equal to the less segment CD . $\square$

Detailed Learning Proof.



The problem is not merely to draw a segment equal to the shorter one; Euclid I.2 already does that. The problem is to place such a segment on the greater given segment. Starting at the endpoint A of the greater segment AB , copy the shorter segment CD to form AD . A circle centered at A with radius AD records exactly that copied length in every direction from A .

Where this circle meets the greater segment AB , call the point E . Then AE is a radius of the circle and so is equal to AD . Since AD was copied from CD , the cut-off segment AE is equal to CD . $\square$

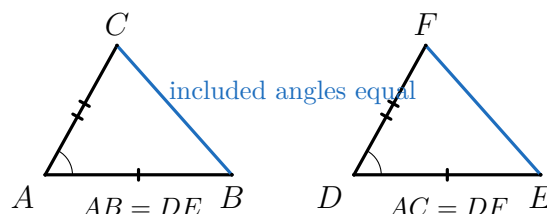
Remark (Proof structure). Euclid I.3 depends on I.2 as a length-copying lemma. Once the shorter segment has been copied from the endpoint of the greater one, Postulate III turns that copied length into the cutoff point on the greater segment.

Remark (Dependencies).

- [Straight line](#)
- [Circle](#)
- [Euclid I.2](#)
- [Euclid Postulate III](#)
- [Euclid Common Notion I](#)

Remark (Return). [Return to Theorem](#)

Theorem (Euclid I.4: Side-angle-side congruence). *If two triangles have two sides equal to two sides respectively, and have the angles contained by the equal straight lines equal, then the bases, the triangles, and the remaining angles are equal respectively.*



Professional Standard Proof.

Let triangles ABC and DEF satisfy $AB = DE$, $AC = DF$, and $\angle BAC = \angle EDF$. Place the point A on D , the straight line AB on DE , and the straight line AC on DF . Since the included angles are equal, the two sides fall along the corresponding sides. Since $AB = DE$, the point B coincides with E ; since $AC = DF$, the point C coincides with F .

Therefore the base BC coincides with the base EF . By Common Notion IV, things which coincide are equal. Hence $BC = EF$, the whole triangle ABC is equal to the whole triangle DEF , and the remaining corresponding angles are equal. $\square$

Detailed Learning Proof.

The diagram is meant to be read by superposition. Equal included angles allow one triangle to be laid on the other without rotating one side away from its mate. The two equal side lengths then force the two non-vertex endpoints to land exactly on the corresponding endpoints. Once the three vertices coincide, the third side and the two remaining angles coincide as well. $\square$

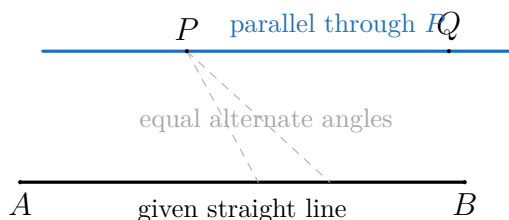
Remark (Proof structure). Superpose one triangle on the other, use the two equal sides to identify the endpoints, and use coincidence to conclude equality of the base and remaining angles.

Remark (Dependencies).

- [Triangle side classes](#)
- [Rectilinear angle](#)
- [Euclid Common Notion IV](#)

Remark (Return). [Return to Theorem](#)

Theorem (Euclid I.31: Drawing a parallel through a point). *Through a given point, to draw a straight line parallel to a given straight line.*



Professional Standard Proof.

Let P be the given point and let AB be the given straight line. Draw a transversal from P to a point on AB . At P , construct an angle equal to the alternate interior angle made by the transversal with AB , and draw the straight line through P forming that equal angle.

The two lines cut by the transversal have equal alternate interior angles. Euclid's parallel criterion, which rests on the parallel postulate, gives that the constructed line through P is parallel to AB . $\square$

Detailed Learning Proof.

The construction copies an angle rather than guessing a direction. Once the angle at P matches the alternate angle at the given line, the transversal sees the same slant at both intersections. In Euclidean geometry that equality of alternate interior angles is exactly the signal that the two straight lines do not meet when produced. $\square$

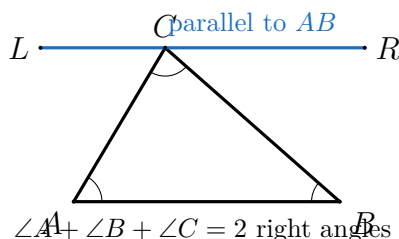
Remark (Proof structure). Draw a transversal, copy the alternate angle at the given point, and invoke the parallel criterion to identify the constructed line as parallel to the given line.

Remark (Dependencies).

- [Parallel straight lines](#)
- [Euclid Postulate I](#)
- [Euclid Postulate V](#)

Remark (Return). [Return to Theorem](#)

Theorem (Euclid I.32: Triangle angle sum). *In any triangle, if one of the sides is produced, then the exterior angle is equal to the two interior and opposite angles, and the three interior angles of the triangle are equal to two right angles.*



Professional Standard Proof.

Let ABC be a triangle. Through C , draw a line parallel to AB by Euclid I.31. The straight line AC cuts the two parallels, so the angle made by AC with the parallel through C equals the interior angle at A . Likewise, the straight line BC cuts the two parallels, so the angle made by BC with the parallel through C equals the interior angle at B .

At the point C , these two copied angles together with the original angle ACB form a straight angle, that is, two right angles. Substituting the equal alternate angles for the angles at A and B , the three interior angles of triangle ABC are equal to two right angles. The same equal-angle comparison also identifies the exterior angle with the sum of the two opposite interior angles. $\square$

Detailed Learning Proof.

The diagram places a parallel to the base through the top vertex. The base angle at A reappears at C on one side of the triangle, and the base angle at B reappears at C on the other side. Along the parallel line through C , those two copied angles and the original vertex angle exactly fill a straight line. A straight line has two right angles, so the three angles of the triangle sum to two right angles. $\square$

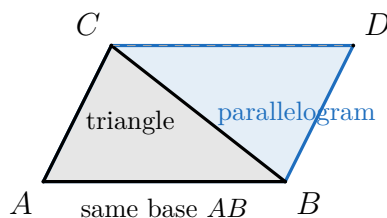
Remark (Proof structure). Draw a parallel through one vertex, transfer the two remote angles by alternate interior angles, and read the three angles as a straight angle.

Remark (Dependencies).

- [Triangle angle classes](#)
- [Euclid I.31](#)
- [Euclid Postulate V](#)

Remark (Return). [Return to Theorem](#)

Theorem (Euclid I.41: Triangle and parallelogram on the same base). *If a parallelogram has the same base with a triangle and is in the same parallels, then the parallelogram is double the triangle.*



Professional Standard Proof.

Let parallelogram $ABDC$ and triangle ABC have the same base AB and lie between the same parallels. Draw the diagonal BC of the parallelogram. The diagonal divides the parallelogram into two triangles on equal bases and in the same parallels. These two triangles coincide in area by the earlier parallel-area comparison.

One of those two triangles is the given triangle ABC . Hence the whole parallelogram consists of two equal copies of that triangle, so the parallelogram is double the triangle. $\square$

Detailed Learning Proof.

Look at the diagonal. It cuts the parallelogram into two triangular halves. Because opposite sides of the parallelogram are parallel, the two halves have matching bases and matching altitude between the same parallel lines. Euclid therefore treats them as equal in area. The parallelogram is the two halves together, while the given triangle is one half. $\square$

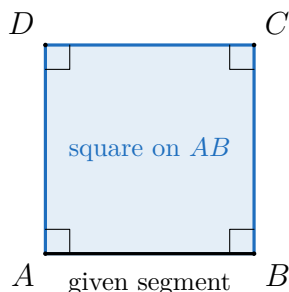
Remark (Proof structure). Cut the parallelogram by a diagonal, compare the two triangular halves, and read the whole parallelogram as two equal copies of the triangle.

Remark (Dependencies).

- [Parallel straight lines](#)
- [Quadrilateral classes](#)
- [Euclid Common Notion IV](#)

Remark (Return). [Return to Theorem](#)

Theorem (Euclid I.46: Constructing a square on a segment). *On a given straight line, to describe a square.*



Professional Standard Proof.

Let AB be the given segment. At A , draw a perpendicular to AB and cut off AD equal to AB . Through D , draw a line parallel to AB ; through B , draw a line parallel to AD . Let those two parallels meet at C .

The quadrilateral $ABCD$ has opposite sides parallel, so it is a parallelogram. The construction gives one right angle, and the parallel lines transfer right angles to the remaining corners. Also $AD = AB$ by construction, and opposite sides of the parallelogram are equal. Thus all four sides are equal and all four angles are right angles. By the definition of a square, $ABCD$ is the square on AB . $\square$

Detailed Learning Proof.

The construction first creates one side perpendicular to the given segment and equal to it. The two parallels then close the quadrilateral without changing the directions: horizontal sides stay parallel to AB , and vertical sides stay parallel to AD . This makes a right-angled parallelogram whose adjacent sides are equal, hence a square. $\square$

Remark (Proof structure). Construct a perpendicular equal side, close the figure with parallels, and use parallel transfer of right angles plus equality of opposite sides to identify a square.

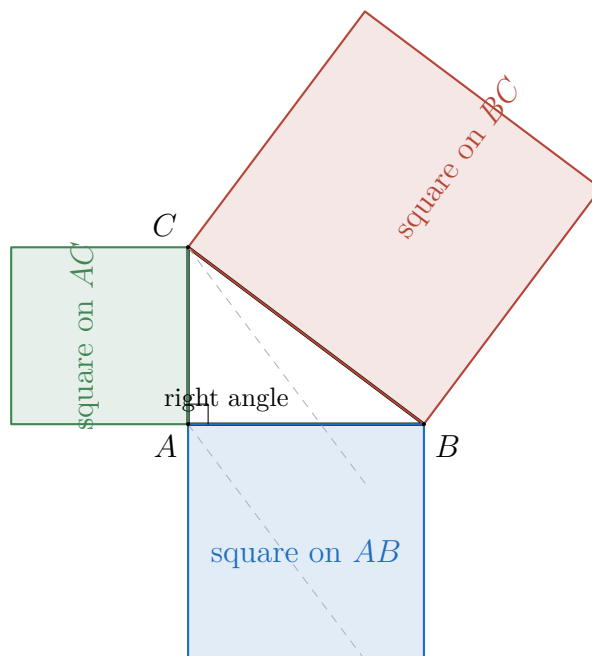
Remark (Dependencies).

- [Square](#)
- [Euclid I.31](#)
- [Euclid Postulate I](#)
- [Euclid Postulate IV](#)

Remark (Return). [Return to Theorem](#)

Theorem (Euclid I.47: Pythagorean theorem). *In right-angled triangles, the square on the side subtending the right angle is equal to the squares on the sides containing the right angle.*

Professional Standard Proof.



Let ABC be a right-angled triangle with right angle at A . Construct the squares on AB , AC , and BC by Euclid I.46. Through A draw the line parallel to the appropriate sides of the square on BC , dividing that square into two rectangles.

By Euclid I.4, the triangles built from the side AB and the corresponding side of the hypotenuse-square are congruent in the required side-angle-side comparison. By Euclid I.41, the square on AB is double one of those triangles, and the matching rectangle in the hypotenuse-square is double the congruent triangle. Hence the square on AB equals that rectangle. The same argument on the side AC shows that the square on AC equals the other rectangle in the hypotenuse-square.

The two rectangles together make up the square on BC . Therefore, by Common Notion II, the square on AB together with the square on AC equals the square on BC . $\square$

Detailed Learning Proof.

Euclid's proof is an area comparison, but not an algebraic computation of areas as real numbers. The square on the hypotenuse is split into two rectangles. One rectangle is shown equal to the square on one leg; the other rectangle is shown equal to the square on the other leg. Since the two rectangles together make up the square on the hypotenuse, the square on the hypotenuse equals the sum of the two leg-squares.

This matters for the later trigonometric construction. When a right triangle is normalized so that its hypotenuse has unit length, Euclid I.47 is the synthetic source of the identity

$$\cos^2 \theta + \sin^2 \theta = 1.$$

The coordinate and area-algebra version of this proof belongs later, after Cartesian coordinates and numerical area have been licensed. $\square$

Remark (Dependency status). This is the Euclidean windmill proof at the level needed for the trigonometric construction. The local spine now records the congruence, parallel, area, and square-construction tools that the proof uses.

Remark (Proof structure). Construct squares on the three sides of a right triangle, split the square on the hypotenuse into two rectangles, prove each rectangle equal to the corresponding square on a leg, and add the two equalities.

Remark (Dependencies).

- [Right angle and perpendicular](#)
- [Right-angled triangle](#)
- [Square](#)
- [Euclid Postulate I](#)
- [Euclid Common Notion II](#)
- [Euclid Common Notion III](#)
- [Euclid I.4](#)
- [Euclid I.41](#)
- [Euclid I.46](#)

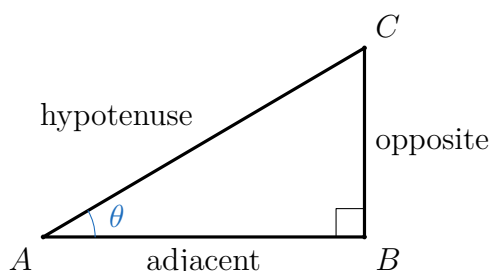
Chapter 2

Trigonometry



2.0.1 Trigonometric Functions from Euclidean Geometry

Remark (Geometric intuition). A right triangle fixes three side lengths relative to an acute angle: opposite, adjacent, and hypotenuse. Similar right triangles may be larger or smaller, but their corresponding side ratios are unchanged. This invariance is what makes a trigonometric ratio a function of the angle rather than a feature of one drawing.



Definition

Definition 2.0.1 (Right-triangle trigonometric ratios). Let T be a right triangle and let θ be one of its acute angles. Write

$$\text{opp}(T, \theta), \quad \text{adj}(T, \theta), \quad \text{hyp}(T)$$

for the side lengths opposite θ , adjacent to θ , and opposite the right angle, respectively. Define

$$\begin{aligned} \sin \theta &= \frac{\text{opp}(T, \theta)}{\text{hyp}(T)}, & \cos \theta &= \frac{\text{adj}(T, \theta)}{\text{hyp}(T)}, & \tan \theta &= \frac{\text{opp}(T, \theta)}{\text{adj}(T, \theta)}, \\ \cot \theta &= \frac{\text{adj}(T, \theta)}{\text{opp}(T, \theta)}, & \sec \theta &= \frac{\text{hyp}(T)}{\text{adj}(T, \theta)}, & \csc \theta &= \frac{\text{hyp}(T)}{\text{opp}(T, \theta)}. \end{aligned}$$

Remark (Standard quantified statement). For every right triangle T and every acute angle θ of T , the six displayed ratios are defined whenever the denominator in the displayed quotient is nonzero.

Remark (Primitive and derived ratios). The primitive geometric ratios are sine and cosine. Tangent, cotangent, secant, and cosecant are convenient quotient or reciprocal ratios built from the same three side lengths.

Remark (Dependencies).

- [Right-angled triangle](#)
- [Right angle and perpendicular](#)

Definition

Definition 2.0.2 (Sine and cosine). For an acute Euclidean angle θ , choose any right triangle T having θ as an acute angle and set

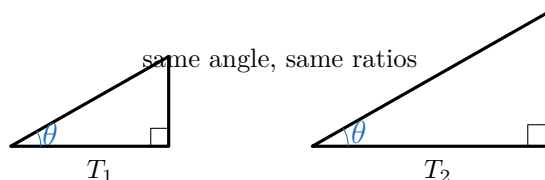
$$\sin \theta = \frac{\text{opp}(T, \theta)}{\text{hyp}(T)}, \quad \cos \theta = \frac{\text{adj}(T, \theta)}{\text{hyp}(T)}.$$

Remark (Standard quantified statement). For every acute Euclidean angle θ , if T is a right triangle having θ as an acute angle, then $\sin \theta$ and $\cos \theta$ are the opposite-over-hypotenuse and adjacent-over-hypotenuse ratios of T .

Remark (Well-definedness debt). This definition depends on the similarity-invariance theorem below. Until that theorem is invoked, the displayed formulas describe a ratio in a chosen triangle, not yet a function of θ alone.

Remark (Dependencies).

- [Right-triangle trigonometric ratios](#)



Theorem

Theorem 2.0.3 (Similarity invariance of trigonometric ratios). *If two right triangles have the same acute angle θ , then their corresponding opposite-to-hypotenuse and adjacent-to-hypotenuse ratios are equal.*

Remark (Proof). [Go to proof](#).

Remark (Standard quantified statement). For all right triangles T_1, T_2 and every acute angle θ , if θ is an acute angle of both triangles, then

$$\frac{\text{opp}(T_1, \theta)}{\text{hyp}(T_1)} = \frac{\text{opp}(T_2, \theta)}{\text{hyp}(T_2)} \quad \text{and} \quad \frac{\text{adj}(T_1, \theta)}{\text{hyp}(T_1)} = \frac{\text{adj}(T_2, \theta)}{\text{hyp}(T_2)}.$$

Remark (Dependencies).

- [Euclid I.32](#)

Theorem

Theorem 2.0.4 (Well-definedness of sine and cosine). *For each acute Euclidean angle θ , the values $\sin \theta$ and $\cos \theta$ are independent of the right triangle chosen to compute them.*

Remark (Proof). [Go to proof.](#)

Remark (Dependencies).

- [Sine and cosine](#)
- [Similarity invariance of trigonometric ratios](#)

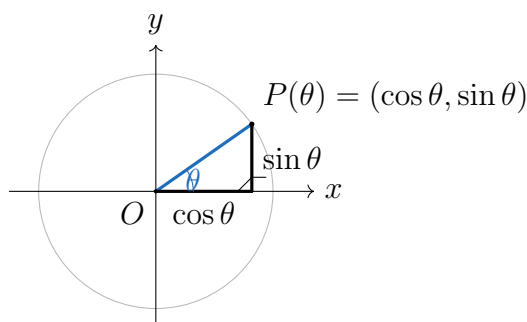
Theorem

Theorem 2.0.5 (Six trigonometric functions). *The six right-triangle trigonometric ratios define functions of an acute Euclidean angle, subject to the denominator restrictions in their defining quotients.*

Remark (Proof). [Go to proof.](#)

Remark (Dependencies).

- [Right-triangle trigonometric ratios](#)
- [Well-definedness of sine and cosine](#)



Definition

Definition 2.0.6 (Unit-circle sine and cosine). Let θ be an angle in standard position, and let $P(\theta) = (x_\theta, y_\theta)$ be the point where its terminal ray meets the unit circle. Define

$$\cos \theta = x_\theta, \quad \sin \theta = y_\theta.$$

Remark (Debt flag). This definition extends sine and cosine beyond acute angles. Treating θ as an arbitrary real-valued radian input requires arc length and rectifiability machinery not yet developed in this volume.

Remark (Dependencies).

- [Circle](#)
- [Cartesian Product](#)
- [Well-definedness of sine and cosine](#)

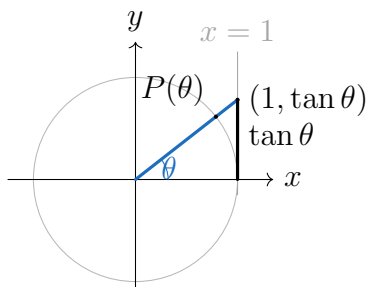
Theorem

Theorem 2.0.7 (Unit-circle agreement with right-triangle trigonometry). *For $0 < \theta < 90^\circ$, the unit-circle definitions of sine and cosine agree with the right-triangle definitions.*

Remark (Proof). [Go to proof.](#)

Remark (Dependencies).

- [Sine and cosine](#)
- [Unit-circle sine and cosine](#)



Definition

Definition 2.0.8 (Extended tangent, cotangent, secant, and cosecant). Where the displayed denominators are nonzero, define

$$\tan \theta = \frac{\sin \theta}{\cos \theta}, \quad \cot \theta = \frac{\cos \theta}{\sin \theta}, \quad \sec \theta = \frac{1}{\cos \theta}, \quad \csc \theta = \frac{1}{\sin \theta}.$$

Remark (Geometric reading). The tangent of θ is the signed height where the terminal ray meets the vertical tangent line $x = 1$.

Remark (Dependencies).

- [Unit-circle sine and cosine](#)
- [Unit-circle agreement with right-triangle trigonometry](#)

Definition

Definition 2.0.9 (Radian measure). One radian is the angle that cuts off arc length 1 on the unit circle. A full turn has measure 2π radians.

Remark (Debt flag). This definition uses arc length intuitively. Its rigorous foundation belongs after rectifiable curves and the construction of π from circumference.

Remark (Dependencies).

- [Unit-circle sine and cosine](#)
- [Circle](#)

Theorem

Theorem 2.0.10 (Symmetry and periodicity of sine and cosine). *For every angle in the unit-circle domain,*

$$\cos(-\theta) = \cos \theta, \quad \sin(-\theta) = -\sin \theta,$$

and one full turn returns the same sine and cosine values.

Remark (Proof). [Go to proof.](#)

Theorem

Theorem 2.0.11 (Pythagorean identity). *For every angle in the unit-circle domain,*

$$\cos^2 \theta + \sin^2 \theta = 1.$$

Remark (Proof). [Go to proof.](#)

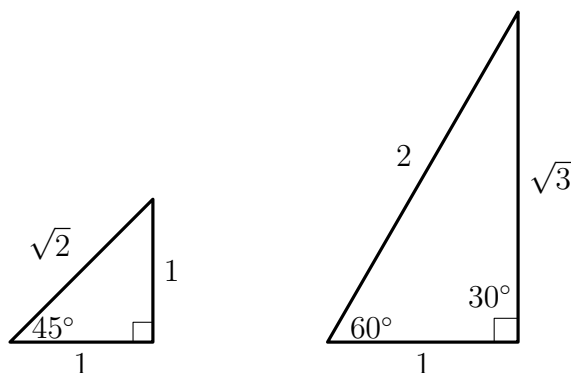
Remark (Dependencies).

- [Euclid I.47](#)
- [Unit-circle sine and cosine](#)

Theorem

Theorem 2.0.12 (Angle-sum and difference identities). *The sine and cosine of a sum or difference of angles are determined by the standard angle-sum and angle-difference formulas.*

Remark (Proof). [Go to proof.](#)



Remark (Special angles). The 45° and 30° – 60° values come from the isosceles right triangle and the bisected equilateral triangle. The radian entries use the radian convention above and inherit its arc-length debt.

Proofs

Remark (Return). [Return to Theorem](#)

Theorem (Similarity invariance of trigonometric ratios). *If two right triangles have the same acute angle θ , then their corresponding opposite-to-hypotenuse and adjacent-to-hypotenuse ratios are equal.*

Professional Standard Proof.

TODO: professional standard proof for trig-ratios-similarity-invariant. □

Detailed Learning Proof.

TODO: detailed learning proof for trig-ratios-similarity-invariant. □

Remark (Proof structure).

Remark (Dependencies).

- TODO: add dependencies for this proof.

Remark (Return). [Return to Theorem](#)

Theorem (Well-definedness of sine and cosine). *For each acute Euclidean angle θ , the values $\sin \theta$ and $\cos \theta$ are independent of the right triangle chosen to compute them.*

Professional Standard Proof.

TODO: professional standard proof for sine-cosine-well-defined. □

Detailed Learning Proof.

TODO: detailed learning proof for sine-cosine-well-defined. □

Remark (Proof structure).

Remark (Dependencies).

- TODO: add dependencies for this proof.

Remark (Return). [Return to Theorem](#)

Theorem (Six trigonometric functions). *The six right-triangle trigonometric ratios define functions of an acute Euclidean angle, subject to denominator restrictions.*

Professional Standard Proof.

TODO: professional standard proof for six-trig-functions. □

Detailed Learning Proof.

TODO: detailed learning proof for six-trig-functions. □

Remark (Proof structure).

Remark (Dependencies).

- TODO: add dependencies for this proof.

Remark (Return). [Return to Theorem](#)

Theorem (Unit-circle agreement with right-triangle trigonometry). *For $0 < \theta < 90^\circ$, the unit-circle definitions of sine and cosine agree with the right-triangle definitions.*

Professional Standard Proof.

TODO: professional standard proof for unit-circle-agrees-with-right-triangle-trig. □

Detailed Learning Proof.

TODO: detailed learning proof for unit-circle-agrees-with-right-triangle-trig. □

Remark (Proof structure).

Remark (Dependencies).

- TODO: add dependencies for this proof.

Remark (Return). [Return to Theorem](#)

Theorem (Symmetry and periodicity of sine and cosine). *For every angle in the unit-circle domain, cosine is even, sine is odd, and one full turn returns the same sine and cosine values.*

Professional Standard Proof.

TODO: professional standard proof for trig-symmetry-periodicity. □

Detailed Learning Proof.

TODO: detailed learning proof for trig-symmetry-periodicity. □

Remark (Proof structure).

Remark (Dependencies).

- TODO: add dependencies for this proof.

Remark (Return). [Return to Theorem](#)

Theorem (Pythagorean identity). *For every angle in the unit-circle domain,*

$$\cos^2 \theta + \sin^2 \theta = 1.$$

Professional Standard Proof.

TODO: professional standard proof for pythagorean-trig-identity. □

Detailed Learning Proof.

TODO: detailed learning proof for pythagorean-trig-identity. □

Remark (Proof structure).

Remark (Dependencies).

- TODO: add dependencies for this proof.

Remark (Return). [Return to Theorem](#)

Theorem (Angle-sum and difference identities). *The sine and cosine of a sum or difference of angles are determined by the standard angle-sum and angle-difference formulas.*

Professional Standard Proof.

TODO: professional standard proof for trig-angle-sum-difference. □

Detailed Learning Proof.

TODO: detailed learning proof for trig-angle-sum-difference. □

Remark (Proof structure).

Remark (Dependencies).

- TODO: add dependencies for this proof.

Chapter 3

Analytical Geometry



3.1 Analytical Geometry

Remark (Status). Notes, proofs, and exercises will appear here in a future revision.

3.2 Lines

Definition

Definition 3.2.1 (Point-slope form). Let $P_1 = (x_1, y_1)$ be a point in the Euclidean plane and let $m \in \mathbb{R}$. The point-slope form of the line through P_1 with slope m is

$$y - y_1 = m(x - x_1).$$

Remark (Standard quantified statement). For every point $P_1 = (x_1, y_1) \in \mathbb{R}^2$ and every $m \in \mathbb{R}$, the corresponding line is the set of all $(x, y) \in \mathbb{R}^2$ satisfying $y - y_1 = m(x - x_1)$.

Remark (Derivation). The formula records the condition that the slope from P_1 to an arbitrary point (x, y) on the line is constant and equal to m .

Remark (Dependencies).

- Real Numbers
- Cartesian Product
- Subtraction on $\mathbb{R}$
- Multiplication on $\mathbb{R}$

Definition

Definition 3.2.2 (Two-point form). Let $P_1 = (x_1, y_1)$ and $P_2 = (x_2, y_2)$ be distinct points with $x_1 \neq x_2$. The two-point form of the line through P_1 and P_2 is

$$y - y_1 = \left(\frac{y_2 - y_1}{x_2 - x_1} \right) (x - x_1).$$

Remark (Standard quantified statement). For all distinct points $P_1 = (x_1, y_1)$ and $P_2 = (x_2, y_2)$ in $\mathbb{R}^2$ with $x_1 \neq x_2$, the line through P_1 and P_2 is the set of all $(x, y) \in \mathbb{R}^2$ satisfying the displayed two-point equation.

Remark (Dependencies).

- [Point-Slope Form](#)
- Subtraction on $\mathbb{R}$
- $\mathbb{R}$ Is a Field

Definition

Definition 3.2.3 (General linear form). The general linear form of a line in $\mathbb{R}^2$ is

$$Ax + By + C = 0,$$

where $A, B, C \in \mathbb{R}$ and $A^2 + B^2 \neq 0$.

Remark (Standard quantified statement). For all $A, B, C \in \mathbb{R}$ with $A^2 + B^2 \neq 0$, the equation $Ax + By + C = 0$ determines a nondegenerate line in $\mathbb{R}^2$.

Remark (Interpretation). The vector (A, B) is normal to the line. This form includes vertical lines and therefore avoids the exceptional cases present in slope-based forms.

Remark (Dependencies).

- Real Numbers
- Addition on $\mathbb{R}$
- Multiplication on $\mathbb{R}$
- $\mathbb{R}$ Is a Field

Definition

Definition 3.2.4 (Vector parametric form). A line in $\mathbb{R}^2$ may be represented as the image of $\mathbf{r} : \mathbb{R} \rightarrow \mathbb{R}^2$ given by

$$\mathbf{r}(t) = \mathbf{r}_0 + t\mathbf{v},$$

where $\mathbf{r}_0 \in \mathbb{R}^2$ is a point on the line and $\mathbf{v} \in \mathbb{R}^2$ is a nonzero direction vector.

Remark (Standard quantified statement). For every $\mathbf{r}_0 \in \mathbb{R}^2$ and every nonzero $\mathbf{v} \in \mathbb{R}^2$, the set $\{\mathbf{r}_0 + t\mathbf{v} : t \in \mathbb{R}\}$ is a line in $\mathbb{R}^2$.

Remark (Dependencies).

- Real Numbers
- Cartesian Product
- Function
- Addition on $\mathbb{R}$
- Multiplication on $\mathbb{R}$

Definition

Definition 3.2.5 (Intercept form). If a line meets the x -axis at $(a, 0)$ and the y -axis at $(0, b)$ with $a, b \neq 0$, its intercept form is

$$\frac{x}{a} + \frac{y}{b} = 1.$$

Remark (Standard quantified statement). For all nonzero $a, b \in \mathbb{R}$, the line with intercepts $(a, 0)$ and $(0, b)$ is the set of all $(x, y) \in \mathbb{R}^2$ satisfying $x/a + y/b = 1$.

Remark (Derivation). The intercept form follows by applying the two-point form to the points $(a, 0)$ and $(0, b)$ and then rearranging the resulting equation.

Remark (Dependencies).

- [Two-Point Form](#)
- $\mathbb{R}$ Is a Field

Definition

Definition 3.2.6 (Affine parametric line in $\mathbb{R}^n$). Given distinct points $\mathbf{x}_1, \mathbf{x}_2 \in \mathbb{R}^n$, the line through them is

$$\mathbf{x}(t) = \mathbf{x}_1 + t(\mathbf{x}_2 - \mathbf{x}_1), \quad t \in \mathbb{R}.$$

Remark (Standard quantified statement). For all distinct $\mathbf{x}_1, \mathbf{x}_2 \in \mathbb{R}^n$, the set $\{\mathbf{x}_1 + t(\mathbf{x}_2 - \mathbf{x}_1) : t \in \mathbb{R}\}$ is the affine line through $\mathbf{x}_1$ and $\mathbf{x}_2$.

Remark (Interpretation). For $0 \leq t \leq 1$, the same formula describes the line segment joining $\mathbf{x}_1$ and $\mathbf{x}_2$. For arbitrary real t , it describes the entire affine line.

Remark (Dependencies).

- Real Numbers
- Cartesian Product

- Subtraction on $\mathbb{R}$
- Addition on $\mathbb{R}$
- Multiplication on $\mathbb{R}$

Definition

Definition 3.2.7 (Normal form). A line in $\mathbb{R}^2$ may be written in normal form as

$$x \cos \alpha + y \sin \alpha - p = 0,$$

where $p \geq 0$ is the distance from the origin to the line.

Remark (Standard quantified statement). For every $p \geq 0$ and every real angle α , the equation $x \cos \alpha + y \sin \alpha - p = 0$ describes a line whose unit normal direction is $(\cos \alpha, \sin \alpha)$.

Remark (Dependencies).

- [General Linear Form](#)
- [Sine and Cosine](#)
- Order on $\mathbb{R}$

Definition

Definition 3.2.8 (Symmetric form). Given a point (x_1, y_1) and direction cosines $(\cos \theta, \sin \theta)$, the symmetric form of a line is

$$\frac{x - x_1}{\cos \theta} = \frac{y - y_1}{\sin \theta} = r.$$

Remark (Standard quantified statement). For every point (x_1, y_1) and every direction with nonzero displayed denominators, the symmetric equation describes the same line as the parametric equations $x = x_1 + r \cos \theta$ and $y = y_1 + r \sin \theta$.

Remark (Dependencies).

- [Vector Parametric Form](#)
- [Sine and Cosine](#)
- $\mathbb{R}$ Is a Field

Proofs

Bibliography

Euclid. *The Thirteen Books of Euclid's Elements*. Dover Publications, 1956.